Bamiyan ruler Shams al-Din Muhammad (r. AH 558–588/1163–1192 CE), since the ruler of Firuzkuh had relinquished this *laqab* in favor of Ghiyath al-Din by AH 588/1163 CE. Hence, the dilemma: the 1160s would be too early for the Shansabanis to have a territorial presence this far east; and yet, it is equally unlikely that the Bamiyan Shansabanis ever reached Gandhara, even at the height of their power in the 1190s CE. Cf. Tye and Tye 1995: 53 and No. 138; also O'Neal 2015. For a parallel instance in the case of Shihab al-Din/Sultan Mu'izz al-Din, see Chapter 1 (notes).

9. Cf. Juzjani vol. I, 1963: 354 (trans. vol. I, 1881: 369). An examination of Shansabani marital alliances could offer additional insight into the differing politico-economic wherewithal and consequent hierarchy among the various lineages. Over time and with Firuzkuh's growing coffers – refilled *via* a trade economy – the Firuzkuhi Shansabanis were able to enter marriage alliances outside Ghur (see main text), which were also more useful than marriage among kin. Meanwhile, the Bamiyan Shansabanis' marriages appear to have been largely among their Shansabani agnates, e.g., the marriage of Sultan Shams al-Din Muhammad (r. 1163–1192), Fakhr al-Din Mas'ud's successor, to Hurra-yi Jalali, the elder sister of the Firuzkuh and Ghazna sultans Ghiyath al-Din and Mu'izz al-Din (respectively), and the mother of the great cultural patron Baha' al-Din of Bamiyan (r. 1192–1206; see main text). Additionally, Malika-yi Jalali, Sultan Ghiyath al-Din's daughter, was betrothed to Baha' al-Din's son and heir Malik 'Ala' al-Din Muhammad. Cf. Juzjani vol. I, 1963: 379, 388 (trans. vol. I, 1881: 412, 428). Barfield (1981: 78) noted that modern nomads in northeastern Afghanistan rarely arranged matches among patrilineal cousins, instead preferring outside alliances and the larger affine networks afforded by such exogamous marriages. By contrast, paternal cousin marriage continues in force among the Arabian Bedouin (Barfield 1993: 77), an old practice that could have been the source of the orthodox Islamic prescriptions for such arrangements.
10. Juzjani vol. I, 1963: 337, 341, 349 (trans. vol. I, 1881: 341). Sourdel-Thomine (1976: 168) proposed that this site was the same as Shah-i Mashhad, citing both Juzjani and Le Strange (1930: 416). However, the location does *not* coincide with Shah-i Mashhad: cf. Glatzer 1973: 67, whose comments on the location are particularly weighty given his rediscovery of the complex, together with M. Casimir, in 1970 (Casimir and Glatzer 1971). See also Najimi 2015: 147; Wannell 2002: 242–243; and *infra* in main text. W. Ball (pers. comm., April 2020) has suggested that Shahr-i Arman could be the historical Afshin – cf. Ball 2019: No. 1033.
11. Juzjani vol. I, 1963: 362–363 (trans. vol. I, 1881: 385). The prominent mention of this individual may indicate that he was actually Muhammad ibn Haisam, the founder of the eponymous Haisamiyya of the later twelfth century. Ibn Haisam put forth significant revisions of Karrami theology and thus established this important "sub-sect" among the Karramiyya, with whom Fakhr al-Din Razi also engaged in his writings. The Haisamiyya were one of three such sub-sects representing later developments in Karrami thought. Cf. Zysow 2011/2012: pt vi.
12. For Taj al-Harir Jauhar Malik, see Juzjani vol. I, 1963: 357 (trans. vol. I, 1881: